

AgentProf: Semantic Profiler for Long Horizon AI Agents

Anonymous submission

Abstract

AI agents increasingly orchestrate long-running, multi-step activities involving thousands to millions of interactions with users, tools, and system resources. To improve quality, safety, and cost efficiency of AI agents, developers need to determine where failures concentrate, which workflows trigger unsafe effects, and which task categories consume the most budget. To answer similar questions in traditional systems software, profiling attributes resource consumption to responsible entities, such as code paths, by aggregation. Yet existing agent observability tools focus on per-execution debugging and tracing rather than profiling, making these questions difficult to answer as trajectories grow long and complex. Agent behavior differs from code execution: the responsible entities are task intent and workflow phase rather than code paths, and agent trajectories lack the stable identifiers that make attribution possible. We propose a *semantic operation stack model* that adapts profiling to agent trajectories. Uniform *operations* represent all agent activities, and *operation stacks* replace the runtime call stack, enabling hierarchical attribution at different levels of granularity from the same data. We observe that an agent’s task occupies a contiguous span of a trajectory and decomposes into contiguous subtasks, so task structure is a set of nested named intervals recoverable by finding only the transitions between them. We therefore design *recursive operation segmentation*, which splits a trajectory where the agent’s responsibility changes, names the intervals on both sides, and recurses to supply the missing stack. AGENTPROF implements this in a profiler that compiles local agent trajectories into pprof-compatible profiles. Our evaluation shows that AGENTPROF effectively attributes resources and locates problems across agent trajectories at practical cost.

Introduction

AI agents (Yang et al. 2024; Anthropic 2025; Xie et al. 2024) orchestrate multi-step activities that span two layers, high-level intent (prompts, LLM calls, tool invocations) and low-level system effects (process spawns, file and network I/O). As agents evolve from short, scripted workflows into complex systems that run for hours and days, with a large number of interactions each, production teams accumulate many such trajectories over weeks or months.

To improve agent quality, safety, and cost efficiency, developers need to analyze operational behavior across trajectories and interactions. Which categories of tasks consume the most token budget? Where do failures concentrate across

This is an anonymized submission for review purposes only. Distribution, citation, or public sharing of this manuscript is strictly prohibited. Copyright and publication details will appear in the final version if accepted.

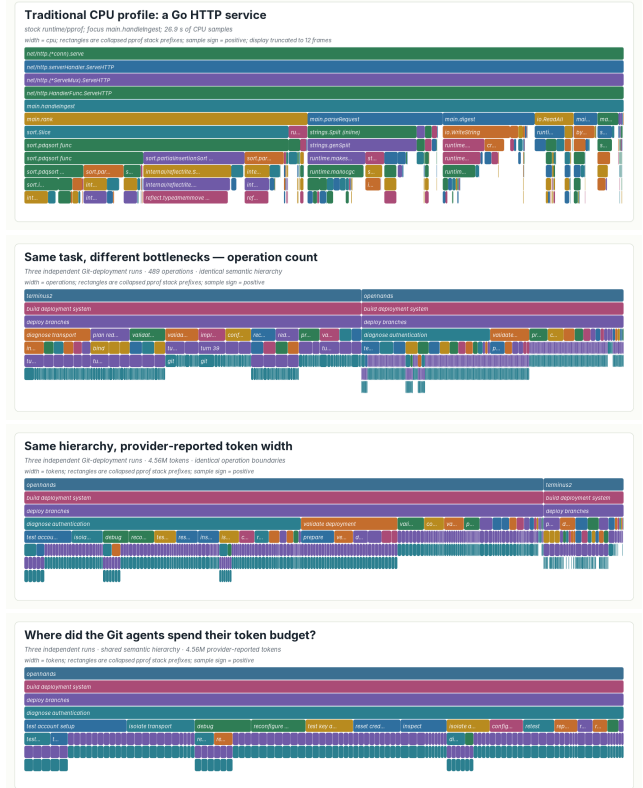


Figure 1: One renderer, four standard pprof profiles. (a) CPU time in a Go HTTP service. (b, c) Three agent executions under one fixed hierarchy: width is operation count (b) or tokens (c). (d) Token profile focused on diagnose authentication.

workflows? Which behavioral patterns trigger unsafe system effects? Answering these questions requires analysis and evaluation across many trajectories (Mazaheri and Mazaheri 2026; Lù et al. 2025), a task becoming costly for manual inspection or per-trajectory LLM evaluation (Zheng et al. 2023) at scale. In traditional systems software, profiling answers these questions by attributing resource consumption to responsible entities by aggregation, as distinct from per-execution debugging and tracing.

Yet existing agent tools support debugging and tracing but not profiling. Some (LangChain 2024; Langfuse 2024; Arize AI 2024a; OpenTelemetry 2024) organize events into per-execution span trees, effective for diagnosing a single run but unable to aggregate by task intent or workflow phase. Others (Datadog 2025; Laminar 2025) cluster inputs or extract structured signals, but characterize *input distributions* (“30% of users ask code questions”) rather than *resource attribution* (“review tasks consume 40% of the token budget”), because tags at the request level do not propagate to downstream tool calls and system effects.

Adapting profiling to agent trajectories is challenging. In traditional software, the responsible entities are code paths. Profiling is straightforward because function names are stable and runtime call nesting provides the attribution hierarchy. Agent behavior differs: to answer the questions above, the responsible entities must be task intent and workflow phase, not code paths. Agent trajectories lack the two properties that make traditional profiling possible. Prompts are natural language, so two prompts expressing the same intent share no common string. Agent events have no runtime call-stack hierarchy because prompts, tool calls, and system effects are not nested by execution the way function calls produce stack frames: a sequence of prompts can be a task or multiple tasks, a task can be part of a bigger task.

Despite these differences, the fundamental profiling methodology transfers to agent trajectories: project resources onto responsible entities, assign stable tags, and attribute hierarchically. We propose a *semantic operation stack model* with two components. *Operations* are uniform records with string fields and additive measures that represent all agent activities (prompts, LLM calls, tool invocations, and system effects) without type-specific objects. *Operation stacks* provide hierarchical attribution, replacing the runtime call stack. Choosing different fields changes the attribution granularity: the same operations can be attributed by task category, by execution phase, by session, or by action type, and one fixed hierarchy replays under any additive measure (Figure 1).

We implement this model in AGENTPROF, an offline profiler that compiles local agent trajectories into pprof-compatible profiles (Figure 2). One algorithm, *recursive operation segmentation*, supplies the missing tags. Its design follows from one observation: a task occupies a contiguous span of a trajectory and decomposes into contiguous subtasks, so task structure is exactly a set of nested named intervals, and recovering it requires only finding the transitions between them. The algorithm finds where responsibility changes, names the resulting intervals, and yields short names starting with a verb (like *diagnose authentication*) that fold across sessions; the interface is implementation-neutral. Across all 405 released CodeTraceBench (Li et al. 2026) trajectories, recursive segmentation agrees with human stage annotations at 0.764 B³ F1 (Bagga and Baldwin 1998), versus 0.663 for a statistical baseline and 0.541 for raw actions. On three complete localization benchmarks, the profile improves ranking over each benchmark’s own diagnostic, raising MAP by 0.031, 0.107, and 0.117. As a navigation aid, it helps an agent reader reach equal ranking quality while opening 53.0% instead of

65.0% of the source evidence. One fixed hierarchy replays under operation-count and token measures with exact conservation, exposing bottlenecks that a count view understates by more than a factor of two.

This paper makes three contributions:

1. **Semantic operation stack model.** We identify the missing profiling layer in agent observability and propose a model of uniform operations and query-time operation stacks (Background and Design).
2. **System: AGENTPROF.** A profiler that implements this model, producing pprof-compatible output.
3. **Evaluation.** We evaluate profiler output against independent ground-truth annotations that stay hidden from the profiler, on eight public benchmarks and three real trajectory populations.

Background and Motivation

LLMs and AI Agents

A typical agent trajectory interleaves two layers of activity. At the intent layer, the agent receives a user prompt, issues LLM calls, and invokes tools (code execution, web search, file editing). Each tool invocation triggers system effects at the lower layer: process spawns, file reads and writes, and network requests. A single trajectory may contain hundreds of cycles between intent and system effects, and a production team accumulates many trajectories over time.

System Profiling

Profiling attributes resource consumption to responsible entities by aggregation, as distinct from per-execution debugging and tracing. In traditional software, the profiling pipeline works as follows: a profiler periodically samples execution state, attaches each sample to the current call stack, and merges samples with identical stacks. Flame graphs (Gregg 2011) and pprof (Google 2024) call graphs visualize the result, where width or node size represents aggregate cost. These tools support flexible aggregation, but they all assume stable function names and a runtime call stack. Pprof’s `tagroot/tagleaf` options can add label-derived pseudo-frames, but only on top of an existing execution stack that agent trajectories do not have.

A Motivating Case

Three independent agent attempts at one real Git-deployment task all failed to deliver the requested password-authenticated endpoint. The developer’s question: *what went wrong, and is it the same problem across all three runs?* Reading three transcripts totaling 489 operations and 4.6M tokens would take hours. Figure 1 places a conventional CPU profile beside the semantic profile of those three runs. Both are standard pprof profiles drawn by one renderer and read by identical rules: width is aggregate cost, a parent contains its children, and identical stacks recorded at different moments fold into one frame. What differs is where the frames come from. A call stack supplies `net/http.(*conn).serve` at every sample for free; nothing in an agent trajectory supplies `diagnose authentication`, because the three runs

express that intent through different prompts and different shell commands. Once that name is constructed, the profile answers the engineer’s question directly.

The profile answers in one view (Figure 1): all three runs share a `diagnose` authentication responsibility that consumes 46% of their combined token budget but only 21% of operation count. Drilldown shows all three executions verifying substitute transport paths without ever establishing the target endpoint. The insight: the agents kept retrying SSH variants instead of fixing the actual credential issue, and operation count alone would hide this because authentication commands are cheap to issue but expensive to verify.

Challenges for Agent Profiling

Adapting profiling to agent trajectories faces two core challenges. The first is that the responsible entities differ. In traditional software, profiling attributes cost to code paths, but in agent trajectories the relevant entities are task intent and workflow phase. Existing tools (OpenTelemetry 2024; Arize AI 2024b) do not capture these entities because prompts are natural language: two prompts expressing the same intent may differ, so the profiler cannot aggregate them the way it aggregates identical function names. The second challenge is that agent trajectories have no runtime hierarchy for attribution. In CPU profiling, the call stack determines attribution at every level: `malloc`’s cost belongs to `parse`, to `process`, and to `main` simultaneously. A sequence of prompts may constitute one task or several, and a task may be part of a larger workflow, but no runtime mechanism marks these boundaries or determines at which granularity to attribute cost.

Design Requirements for Agent Profiling

Agent profiling needs the three mechanisms that call stacks provide automatically, but must achieve them without a call stack: **R1** (cross-layer projection): connect system-layer consumption to intent-level categories; **R2** (stable tags): derive short, repeatable tags from natural-language prompts before folding; **R3** (hierarchical attribution): construct attribution hierarchies from data, not execution nesting.

Design

The three requirements (cross-layer resource projection, stable tags, and hierarchical attribution) drive the design. Operations satisfy R1 by representing intent and system-effect activities in a single record with tag inheritance, so intent tags propagate to the system effects they trigger. *Recursive operation segmentation* satisfies R2 and R3 together: it derives short, stable interval names from trajectory content and nests those intervals into the attribution hierarchy that replaces the runtime call stack. *Operation stacks* then attribute resources at every level of that hierarchy at query time, so the same data supports multiple views without rebuilding the input. The profiling pipeline has four stages: (1) parse raw trajectories into operations, (2) segment trajectories into named nested intervals (or apply mapping rules), (3) project each operation onto a stack frame sequence chosen at query time, and (4) fold operations with identical stacks, summing their weights.

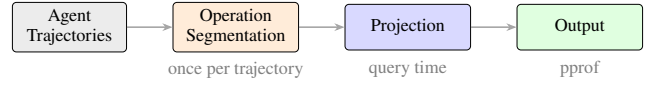


Figure 2: Data-flow pipeline. Local histories and public datasets both produce uniform operations; segmentation runs once, projection and folding at query time.

Semantic Operation Stack Model

Because agent activities span both intent and system-effect layers, a profiler should not distinguish between them in the data representation. AGENTPROF therefore represents every activity as a single abstraction, the *operation*, a weighted record with string fields and additive measures. Each operation carries string fields (`project`, `agent`, `session`, `prompt_tag`, `kind`, `model`, `path`, `domain`, `status`, ...) and additive measures (token count, duration, event count). A prompt, an LLM call, a tool invocation, a file read, a GUI click, and a process event are all operations with the same schema, distinguished only by which fields carry values.

An *operation stack* provides hierarchical attribution for agent trajectories, replacing the runtime call stack. In CPU profiling, the call stack determines which code paths share responsibility for a resource cost. An operation stack serves the same role: an ordered list of fields $[f_1, f_2, \dots, f_k]$ projects each operation o to a frame sequence $\langle o.f_1, o.f_2, \dots, o.f_k \rangle$, and operations with identical sequences are merged, summing their weights. Unlike a call stack, the fields are chosen at query time, not determined by execution. The same operations can therefore be attributed as a flat task summary, a per-session tree, a semantic phase/action hierarchy, or a trajectory using the dataset’s own annotations, and changing the fields changes the attribution without changing the data. Sessions and spans are optional operation fields, not fixed hierarchy levels, so the same data supports both debugging views (include `session`) and aggregate profiling views (exclude it). The frame sequence need not come from fields alone: recursive segmentation supplies each operation’s covering interval-name chain as a variable depth frame sequence, and field lists and interval paths compose in one stack. A view is a triple (φ, σ, w) : a predicate φ selects which operations participate, a stack function $\sigma = [f_1, \dots, f_k]$ maps each operation to its frame sequence, and a weight function w assigns a nonnegative measure. Built-in views cover common questions (e.g., `tokens`, `time`, `files`).

Recursive Operation Segmentation

The algorithm rests on one structural intuition: an agent’s task occupies a contiguous span of the trajectory, and it decomposes into smaller contiguous subtasks. Task structure is therefore exactly a set of nested named intervals, and recovering it only requires finding the transition points between them.

Because agent work has no predefined taxonomy but transitions are visible in the content, the core algorithm is segmentation, not labeling. Instead of assigning each step a

class, the algorithm reads a trajectory and finds the transition points where the agent’s responsibility changes. At each transition it cuts the trajectory and names the intervals on both sides; it then recurses into each interval, cutting again whenever a finer responsibility change remains, and stops when an interval reads as one coherent piece of work. Formally, a trajectory is an ordered step sequence $T = (t_1, \dots, t_n)$, and a segmentation is a set S of named intervals over T that is nested (any two intervals are disjoint or one contains the other), covers every step, and contains the session-wide interval as its root. The algorithm computes S by one recursive rule: `SEGMENT( $I$ )` selects zero or more transition points inside interval I , which partition I into consecutive child intervals; each child receives a short name starting with a verb and is segmented recursively; selecting no transition terminates the branch. A step’s operation path is the name chain of the intervals containing it, from the session root to its innermost interval; equal paths fold across sessions. Segmentation is the right primitive for three reasons. First, transitions are what a trajectory actually exhibits: agent work has no predefined taxonomy, but a shift in what the agent is trying to do is visible in the source content itself. Second, cuts compose: nested intervals form a hierarchy whose depth emerges per branch from the content rather than from a prescribed schema. Third, naming intervals rather than steps yields identifiers at the granularity where recurrence lives, so the same short name starting with a verb (one to three words) reappears across sessions and folds. Concretely, in one Git-deployment execution the algorithm cuts the session into `build deployment system` and, inside it, cuts again where the agent stops writing configuration and starts debugging access, yielding `deploy branches` and `diagnose authentication`; a step inside the latter carries the path `build deployment system > diagnose authentication`, and because the same names reappear in the other two executions, their costs fold together in Figure 1. Any implementation able to find transitions and name intervals (an agent, a language model, or a statistical rule) can serve as the segmenter. In evaluation, we use Codex (OpenAI 2025) with GPT-5.6-sol-high, with one fixed instruction per trajectory:

Input: one trajectory (each step’s prompt, command, and output summary, with no labels or scores).

Action: read it, emit a mark wherever the responsibility changes, and use AGENTPROF to check and update the segmentation, and re-read and update the marks iteratively until you think the segmentation is complete.

Output: sparse path marks, e.g.,

```
step 1: [deploy git server]
step 4: [deploy git server, diagnose
SSH access]
step 15: [deploy git server, verify web
endpoint]
—one line only where the path changes; names start with a
verb, one to three words.
```

The sparse marks still produce a complete segmentation: steps between two marks inherit the preceding path. Segmentation is not a one-shot labeling pass: the agent can revise marks, refine interval names, and add deeper cuts iteratively until it judges the hierarchy complete. Revisions are incre-

mental: changing one interval does not require re-annotating the entire trajectory. Although we evaluate segmentation offline, the model also supports online incremental annotation during agent execution.

Implementation

AGENTPROF is implemented as a Rust CLI (~9.8K LOC, Figure 2). It reads Codex and Claude Code local JSONL history files and AgentSight (Zheng et al. 2025) recordings for system effects. The pipeline has two stages: first, preprocessing extracts a readable trajectory summary; then, the segmentation agent reads this summary and writes interval marks to an annotation file, which it can revise until satisfied. The CLI validates that marks are nested and cover every step, then emits a standard pprof protobuf profile that `go tool pprof` reads directly. Projection is deterministic: each operation contributes its semantic path and LLM/tool evidence, with session identities kept as pprof labels rather than visible frames, so equal semantic prefixes fold across sessions. Switching the additive measure replays the same annotations and changes only stack widths.

Levels need not come from annotation: fields already recorded literally (e.g., agent skill invocations) become stack levels without annotation cost and compose with annotated semantic levels in one hierarchy. Multi-agent orchestration is a direct instance: when an outer agent delegates to a sub-agent (e.g., Claude Code spawning an Explore agent to search code), the delegation is an operation whose interval contains all downstream work, so subagent operations inherit the outer agent’s semantic path without special handling. A non-LLM statistical segmenter is also available: it scores adjacent action transitions by normalized pointwise mutual information (Bouma 2009) and calibrates an unsupervised cutoff with one-dimensional k -means ($k = 2$) (MacQueen 1967), reading only action sequences without target annotations.

Evaluation

We evaluate on three data classes. *Real inputs:* 41 long-horizon coding-agent sessions (three of which repeat one Git-deployment task and form the RQ1 case), 440 mixed web-agent trajectories (Lù et al. 2025), and one developer’s complete local session history from the authors’ workstation (1,394 sessions), whose 42 long-horizon development sessions are the annotated portion. *Annotated trajectories:* 405 CodeTraceBench trajectories with 20,866 operations and 2,948 human-annotated stages (Li et al. 2026), 287 OSWorld-Human sessions (WukLab 2025), 1,012 AgentBoard goals (Ma et al. 2024), and 2,737 published action labels (Bouzenia and Pradel 2025). *Problem-localization benchmarks:* the complete AgentProcessBench, HINTBench, and TraceElephant workloads, where every trajectory carries an independently annotated faulty step, over 27,346 operations (Fan et al. 2026; Wang et al. 2026b; Chen et al. 2026a). All annotations, outcomes, and scores stay hidden from every method until its output is produced. Mean operations per trajectory are 8.5 (AgentProcessBench), 13.9 (OSWorld-Human), 24.0 (HINTBench), 27.1 (TraceElephant), and 51.5 (CodeTraceBench), so the

benchmark trajectories are short to medium length while the annotated 42-session workstation portion (whose longest sessions span tens of hours) supplies long-horizon coverage; the RQ4 union covers 27,765 operations.

RQ1: Does Semantic Profiling Improve Resource Attribution?

Setup. If semantic profiling improves resource attribution, then the same fixed hierarchy should (1) reunite cross-run responsibility that alternative organizations scatter, and (2) reveal materially different bottlenecks when the additive measure changes. We test both on 41 real long-horizon agent trajectories (3,146 user turns, 5,750 operations), including three independent executions of one Git-deployment task whose 735 steps receive 96 recursive annotations reaching semantic depth five.

The motivating case revisited. The Git-deployment case from Section established that semantic organization reunites cross-run responsibility that alternative organizations scatter; here we add a third measure (elapsed time) to show measure-sensitivity. The same hierarchy replays under all three measures with exact conservation, and the `diagnose authentication subtree`'s share rises from 21% (count) through 37% (time) to 46% (tokens). Changing only the measure moves the attributed share by more than a factor of two. A quantitative control shows why both alternatives fail. *Raw-action grouping* (by literal action-type, e.g., `run`, `edit`) fails: of 105 authentication operations, 102 carry only the label `run`, and that same bucket mixes in 97 unrelated operations; a coarser action-kind grouping scatters the work across six kinds (execute 39%, version-control 22%, edit 19%, inspect 12%, search 7%, install 1%). *Native call trees* (each operation under its source LLM or tool call) place each operation under a distinct source call with no shared responsibility node. Only the semantic hierarchy reunites authentication into one focusable cross-run path while preserving all call/tool evidence as drilldown leaves. Separately, real AgentSight (Zheng et al. 2025) eBPF recordings replay the same way: all 1,520 captured process spawns and file operations fold under task responsibilities with exact conservation, demonstrating the system-effect layer end to end.

Use case 2: where did this project's agent budget go?

A developer spent weeks building AGENTPROF and this paper with coding agents, accumulating a local session history whose long-horizon portion (42 sessions, 18 Codex and 24 Claude Code, with 1,252 prompts, 5,620 LLM calls, and 1.38 billion tokens) is annotated here. The question: *what did the agents actually spend tokens doing?* The profile shows the answer is not one dominant sink but a broad distribution: the largest path (`refine paper > align evaluation`) holds only 1.7% of tokens. The three longest sessions (spanning tens of hours each) keep distinct dominant responsibilities (evaluation alignment, evidence inspection, and merge resolution). Switching to operation count shifts where mass concentrates: token mass stays at prompt depth (70%), while operation mass resolves deeper (44% at depths three and four). The history also demonstrates multi-agent composition at scale: 98 subagent delegations across 14 sessions,

where each delegation contains all downstream subagent operations and composes with annotated semantic levels.

The same hierarchy replays under FILE-READ, FILE-WRITE, and NETWORK-target widths with exact conservation of 737, 31, and 61 target references; in the FILE-WRITE view, each created file appears as an exact drilldown leaf beneath the operation that created it. These views answer the Introduction's system-effect question concretely: every recorded file and network target is attributed to the semantic responsibility that touched it, making side effects auditable per responsibility.

Skill invocations appear literally in the session log, so that level costs no annotation time and carries no tag error, and it therefore covers the developer's complete history rather than only its annotated portion: 1,394 sessions and 6,890,216,049 tokens. A skill scope opens at an exact recorded invocation and closes at the next invocation or the next user prompt, which keeps the intervals nested, non-crossing, and covering, and the level conserves exactly. Under it, `paper-writing-style` leads by both measures (29,143,650 tokens and 523 operations over 20 sessions and 37 invocations), and 99.47% of its tokens are cache reads, naming its repeated-context workflow as the first thing to inspect. The largest single session holds only 31.23% of that mass, so the priority across the full history appears only after folding.

Across 440 AgentRewardBench trajectories (7,229 operations, 51,904,621 tokens, both conserved exactly), ranking operations by count versus tokens yields high agreement: mean Kendall's tau-b is 0.886 [0.857, 0.915] over the 77 tasks with at least three distinct operations, and pooled ranking agrees at tau-b 0.929. However, 10 of 77 tasks fall below 0.7, so the measure matters when it matters.

Takeaway. Both conditions hold: the semantic hierarchy reunites cross-run responsibility that raw-action and native organizations scatter (the authentication case), and switching the measure on that fixed hierarchy moves attributed share by more than $2\times$ (21% to 46%), revealing bottlenecks that operation count alone would hide.

RQ2: Does Profiler Output Correspond to Real Problems?

Setup. To evaluate whether profiler output corresponds to independently annotated real problems, we apply three tests: (1) *differential analysis* checks whether the profile's failure structure matches expert behavioral labels across 440 runs; (2) *localization* checks whether adding profile scores to existing benchmark judges improves fault ranking; (3) *reading study* checks whether semantic names help an agent reader reach the same ranking while opening less evidence.

Use case 3: what do failing runs do differently? A team has 440 web-agent runs (Lù et al. 2025) over 125 tasks, where every task has both successful and failed attempts (202 successful, 238 failed). The question: *what behavior separates success from failure?* Reading 440 transcripts (7,229 operations) is infeasible. We pair each failed run with a successful run on the same task (338 pairs), build a profile for each group, and subtract (failed minus successful) to get a signed

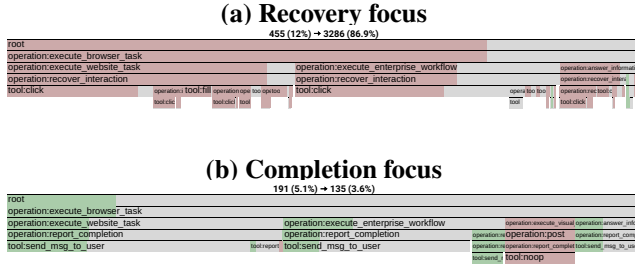


Figure 3: Stock-pprof differential flame graphs (bad minus good). Box width sums both contributions; inset shows net difference (rose: bad excess; green: good excess). Recovery dominates bad runs; completion favors good runs.

difference profile (Figure 3). The answer is immediate: failed runs spend disproportionately more effort on recovery—44.6% of their steps in `recover interaction` (retrying, re-searching, re-navigating) versus only 12.0% for successful runs. Drilldown decomposes the recovery responsibility into verification challenges, repeated searches, mistaken navigation, and record retries, with source labels identifying which sessions contributed each width. The insight: failing agents get stuck in retry loops rather than backing out and trying a different approach. This structure matches independent expert looping labels on 435 trajectories at AP .634 versus prevalence .398 (difference interval [.181, .293]), confirming the profile surfaces a real behavioral pattern; a fixed-chain repeated/error control reaches the same detection quality (AP .656), while only the recursive profile provides the decomposition above with drilldown to source.

Supplementing benchmark’s own diagnostics. *Setup.* Each benchmark trajectory has one annotated faulty step; a method outputs a ranking of that trajectory’s operations, scored by average precision (AP approximates the reciprocal rank of the faulty step) and averaged as MAP (Robertson 2008). We run the complete AgentProcessBench, HINT-Bench (the complete released test snapshot, 536 of the paper-reported 629 trajectories), and TraceElephant workloads; all profiler outputs are computed before any fault annotations are revealed. We report per-query AP averaged over 614, 400, and 220 labeled queries; 522 unlabeled trajectories are consumed for population coverage but excluded from MAP. The *direct diagnostic* is the per-operation output of each benchmark’s own judge, including LLM-as-judge methods: reads the full trace and reference answer before naming the responsible agent and decisive step. *Direct-only* ranks by that diagnostic alone; *Direct+AGENTPROF* breaks ties by group score (vote mean for AgentProcessBench; 95% Wilson bound otherwise), with HINTBench field order fixed on 80 validation trajectories; *Direct+AGENTPROF-Raw* is an ablation that replaces semantic interval names with raw action types (the grouping structure is identical; only the names differ); *AgentProf-only* uses only the profiler without the benchmark diagnostic.

Results. Direct+AGENTPROF beats Direct-only by 0.031

[0.024, 0.039], 0.107 [0.093, 0.120], and 0.117 [0.088, 0.148] (95% intervals from 10,000 paired resamples); all intervals lie above zero, so every improvement is statistically significant. The corresponding AGENTPROF-minus-AGENTPROF-Raw intervals are [-.0003, .0029], [-.0116, .0103], and [-.0247, .0280], all spanning zero. Grouping with retained evidence drives the ranking gain; semantic naming adds a distinct measured benefit: it concentrates the reader’s attention, reducing evidence opened from 65% to 53% at equal quality (measured below). The semantic prefix also enables cross-run attribution (RQ1).

Profile-guided reading on TraceElephant. On the complete 220 queries that contain a faulty step, a Grok 4.5 (xAI 2026) agent (agent-as-judge) receives the task description and trajectory content (without any ground-truth labels) and is asked to rank operations by likely fault. Full-trace reading (without AGENTPROF) reaches MAP .502 at a mean 12,615 input tokens per query, versus .209 for the benchmark’s Direct-only diagnostic and .326 for Direct+AGENTPROF. A profile-guided variant uses the semantic skeleton to select at most five groups and opens only their evidence. The semantic skeleton reaches MAP .455 while opening 53.0% of the source content; AGENTPROF-Raw opens 65.0% at unchanged MAP (.465; paired $\Delta = +.010$ [-.021, +.042]; content $\Delta = +.120$ [+ .103, +.137]). A per-query full read is also bounded by the model context window (the 4,558,192-token Git population cannot be read whole). *Takeaway.* Failure structure surfaced by the profile matches independent human labels across 435 trajectories; profiles add localization signal on top of existing judges; semantic names concentrate the agent’s attention, reducing evidence opened from 65% to 53% at equal ranking quality.

RQ3: How Accurate Are the Tags?

Setup. To evaluate whether recursive segmentation recovers task structure that humans would recognize, we compare segmentation output against 2,948 human-annotated stages over all 405 CodeTraceBench trajectories. F1 (Bagga and Baldwin 1998) asks whether operations that belong together end up grouped together; exact adjacent-boundary F1 (Ruokola et al. 2016) asks whether cuts land exactly where humans cut. Baselines receive identical inputs (Table 1). Each method output is evaluated at the level it predicts: literal names by accuracy and macro-F1 (Lewis et al. 2004), permutation-invariant partitions by V-measure (Rosenberg and Hirschberg 2007) or ordinary B^3 , and adjacent interval boundaries by exact precision, recall, and F1; for legacy field-valued datasets a conversion step maps each predicted group into the same interval-annotation format before AGENTPROF folds the original additive weights. Codex (OpenAI 2025) receives each trajectory (prompts, commands, and output summaries, with no labels or scores visible) and emits sparse interval marks over 17,148 steps without access to stage annotations (loaded after all 405 outputs were fixed): 4,496 marks at semantic depth one (3), two (2,873), three (1,588), or four (32), with no prompt requesting a specific depth. Name normalization then maps the 3,895 free-form interval names to 783 stable short names (e.g., `diagnose authentication`) with

Method	B ³ P	B ³ R	B ³ F1	Bound. F1
Codex segmentation	0.793	0.736	0.764	0.480
Multi-resolution recurrence	0.782	0.575	0.663	0.266
Causal Qwen2.5-3B task stack	0.557	0.792	0.650	0.257
Raw-action grouping	0.891	0.388	0.541	—
Native source tree	0.975	0.249	0.397	0.259
Source-native step	0.983	0.221	0.361	0.246

Table 1: Agreement with human stages on all 405 CodeTraceBench trajectories.

zero adjacent display-path collisions, rejecting unresolved ones; identical names across sessions merge so that recurring work folds in the final profile.

Results. Codex segmentation reaches 0.764 B³ F1 and 0.480 boundary F1, beating the strongest automatic baseline (multi-resolution recurrence) by +0.101 [0.087, 0.116] and +0.214 [0.193, 0.235] (paired task-cluster intervals). A stateful per-turn Qwen2.5-3B baseline that makes push/replace/stay/pop decisions reaches 0.650 B³ F1 and 0.257 boundary F1, confirming that smaller models with carefully designed interfaces can produce meaningful segmentation, though Codex still leads by a substantial margin. The marks conserve exactly 20,866 operations and 494,862,929 tokens. Predicted groups remain largely pure subsets of gold stages (B³ precision 0.793), and the residual boundary error is over-segmentation rather than missed transitions (boundary recall 0.626, precision 0.389): when segmentation disagrees with human stages, it subdivides work rather than merging unrelated responsibilities, preserving per-group coherence for downstream drilldown. The interface generalizes across method families. On 287 OSWorld-Human sessions (3,978 operations, 2,042 human groups), a supervised Bernoulli Naive Bayes boundary predictor (McCallum and Nigam 1998) with five-fold cross-validation reaches 0.739 boundary F1 / 0.816 B³ F1. Calibrated recurrence reaches 0.734 / 0.801 using group annotations the unsupervised default avoids. The no-LLM recurrence segmenter reaches 0.680 / 0.786 (strongest control: 0.645 / 0.678). An unsupervised TF-IDF/K-Means method reaches V-measure 0.557 on nine Mind2Web sessions and 0.815 on 100 ScienceWorld sessions (Deng et al. 2023; Wang et al. 2022). The same Codex instruction without adaptation uses coarser task-level boundaries (0.448 B³ F1); matching OSWorld’s finer action-group granularity recovers 0.816, showing the framework supports different segmentation scales. For closed-label literal tags, a fixed evaluation-only Qwen3.6-27B (Qwen Team 2026) classifier labels all 1,012 AgentBoard goals (Ma et al. 2024) into nine task families at 0.695 macro-F1 and 0.733 accuracy (majority baseline 0.044 / 0.248). The same model classifies 2,737 published action labels from 120 AutoCodeRover, OpenHands, and RepairAgent trajectories (Sajadi et al. 2026; Bouzenia and Pradel 2025) at 0.498 macro-F1 and 0.628 accuracy (majority baseline 0.061 / 0.323). The action classifier’s 0.437 macro-F1 gain has a 95% bootstrap interval of [0.380, 0.494]; excluding 39 AutoCodeRover inputs that literally contain the target word `locate` leaves 0.490 macro-F1, so the positive

Workload	Ops	Semantic (s)	Raw action (s)	Peak RSS (MiB)
AgentRewardBench	729	0.04	0.03	19.3
SATraj-OS	4,285	0.17	0.14	73.9
OSWorld-Human	6,010	0.24	0.21	109.1
AgentNet	16,741	0.70	0.58	279.3
Union	27,765	1.16	0.97	465.2

Table 2: RQ4 profile-construction cost (Chen et al. 2026b; Wang et al. 2025): three-run median times and largest semantic-profile peak RSS. The 729-operation AgentRewardBench row is the fixed public release sample used for cost measurement, distinct from RQ2’s 7,229-operation mixed population.

comparison is unchanged. *Takeaway.* Recursive segmentation recovers human-recognizable task structure: 0.764 B³ F1 against human stages, beating the strongest automatic baseline by +0.101. When segmentation disagrees with humans, it over-segments (subdivides work) rather than merging unrelated responsibilities, preserving per-group coherence. Non-LLM methods implementing the same interface remain viable when no model is available.

RQ4: What Is the Profiling Cost?

Setup. To evaluate whether profiling cost is practical, we measure segmentation time and tokens and profile replay speed. Cost separates into a one-time automatic segmentation pass per corpus and deterministic construction/replay afterwards (Table 2).

Results. Segmenting all 405 CodeTraceBench trajectories with Codex (GPT-5.6-sol-high) consumes 12,050,384 input and 231,886 output tokens in 37 minutes of active backend wall time. A full end-to-end segmentation pass on 440 trajectories completes in 58.7 minutes on two fixed workers, consuming 12,039,417 input and 312,433 output tokens, or 27,362 input and 710 output tokens per trajectory. With marks fixed, construction scales linearly across the five input sizes (Table 2), adding only 5.25 MiB (1.14%) peak RSS over raw-action grouping at the union scale. Deterministic materialization of the full 440-trajectory population takes 0.26 s for operations and 0.25 s for tokens, so construction cost is dominated by the segmentation step while materialization stays sub-second. *Takeaway.* The cost is practical: segmentation is a one-time pass costing minutes of backend time per corpus (37 min for 405 trajectories); every later view, measure switch, and drilldown costs about one second.

Related Work

Classic profilers fold runtime call stacks over stable code identity, and Pivot Tracing groups causally related measurements (Google 2024; Gregg 2011; Mace, Roelke, and Fonseca 2015). Agent observability platforms such as LangSmith, Langfuse, and Phoenix (LangChain 2024; Langfuse 2024; Arize AI 2024a) record spans with metadata for per-execution debugging; analytics layers such as Datadog Patterns and LangSmith Insights (Datadog 2026; LangChain

2026) roll up cross-trace hierarchies or input distributions; but none constructs recursive semantic responsibility with conserved additive measures in a standard profile. Cross-run analyses (TraceProbe, Graphectory, Act-onomy, CHIEF, Hodoscope, TraceGraph) (Shu et al. 2026; Liu et al. 2026a; Gao et al. 2026; Wang et al. 2026c; Zhong, Saxena, and Raghunathan 2026; Nian et al. 2026) and per-run diagnosis and localization (Barke et al. 2026; Wang et al. 2026a; Mazaheri and Mazaheri 2026; Liu et al. 2026b; Mulian et al. 2026; Li et al. 2026; Fan et al. 2026; Wang et al. 2026b; Chen et al. 2026a; In et al. 2026) answer what an agent did and which step went wrong. AGENTPROF instead asks how much of an additive resource a task or workflow phase is responsible for. It recovers variable-depth responsibility from source content (where Act-onomy fixes three levels and TraceProbe one), conserves measures exactly across count, token, and time widths, keeps LLM/tool calls as drilldown leaves, and emits standard pprof. No compared system provides all four, and AGENTPROF stays complementary to per-run diagnosis, as RQ2 measures directly.

Conclusion

Agent observability needs profiling, not only debugging. AGENTPROF shows that the semantic operation stack model, driven by recursive operation segmentation, brings hierarchical attribution to agent trajectories. Against independent annotations, segmentation recovers human stage structure at 0.764 B³ F1, profiles add localization signal on three complete public benchmarks, and one hierarchy replays across additive measures with exact conservation. A strong agent reader that re-reads a whole trajectory per question remains the best single-query localizer, confirming that profilers and debuggers are complementary: the profile answers population questions and guides the agent to the evidence worth opening. Multi-project evaluation and tracing-ecosystem integration are the most impactful next steps.

References

- Anthropic. 2025. Claude Code: An Agentic Coding Tool. <https://code.claude.com/docs/en/overview>.
- Arize AI. 2024a. Arize Phoenix. <https://arize.com/docs/phoenix>.
- Arize AI. 2024b. OpenInference Specification. <https://arize-ai.github.io/openinference/spec/>.
- Bagga, A.; and Baldwin, B. 1998. Entity-Based Cross-Document Coreferencing Using the Vector Space Model. In *36th Annual Meeting of the Association for Computational Linguistics and 17th International Conference on Computational Linguistics, Volume 1*, 79–85.
- Barke, S.; Goyal, A.; Khare, A.; Singh, A.; Nath, S.; and Bansal, C. 2026. AgentRx: Diagnosing AI Agent Failures from Execution Trajectories. arXiv preprint arXiv:2602.02475.
- Bouma, G. 2009. Normalized (Pointwise) Mutual Information in Collocation Extraction. In *From Form to Meaning: Processing Texts Automatically, Proceedings of the Biennial GSCL Conference 2009*, 31–40.
- Bouzenia, I.; and Pradel, M. 2025. Understanding Software Engineering Agents: A Study of Thought-Action-Result Trajectories. In *2025 IEEE/ACM 40th International Conference on Automated Software Engineering (ASE)*, 2846–2857.
- Chen, M.; Wang, J.; Mu, F.; Wang, Y.; Liu, Z.; Feng, H.; and Wang, Q. 2026a. Seeing the Whole Elephant: A Benchmark for Failure Attribution in LLM-Based Multi-Agent Systems. arXiv preprint arXiv:2604.22708.
- Chen, X.; Yin, Z.; He, S.; Huang, B.; Lei, S.; et al. 2026b. Safactory: A Scalable Agentic Infrastructure for Training Trustworthy Autonomous Intelligence. arXiv preprint arXiv:2605.06230.
- Datadog. 2025. LLM Observability. https://docs.datadoghq.com/llm_observability/.
- Datadog. 2026. LLM Observability Patterns. https://docs.datadoghq.com/llm_observability/monitoring/patterns/.
- Deng, X.; Gu, Y.; Zheng, B.; Chen, S.; Stevens, S.; Wang, B.; Sun, H.; and Su, Y. 2023. Mind2Web: Towards a Generalist Agent for the Web. In *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems 36 (NeurIPS), Datasets and Benchmarks Track*.
- Fan, S.; Ye, X.; Huo, Y.; Chen, Z.-Y.; Guo, Y.; Yang, S.; Yang, W.; Ye, S.; Chen, J.; Chen, H.; Cong, X.; and Lin, Y. 2026. AgentProcessBench: Diagnosing Step-Level Process Quality in Tool-Using Agents. In *Proceedings of KDD*.
- Gao, J.; Sun, K.; Huang, J.-t.; Van Koeveering, K.; Ji, S.; Huang, H.; Shi, W.; Lu, Z.; Xiao, Z.; Khashabi, D.; and Dredze, M. 2026. How to Interpret Agent Behavior. arXiv:2605.13625.
- Google. 2024. pprof. <https://github.com/google/pprof>.
- Gregg, B. 2011. Flame Graphs. <https://www.brendangregg.com/flamegraphs.html>.
- In, Y.; Tanjim, M.; Subramanian, J.; Kim, S.; Bhattacharya, U.; Kim, W.; Park, S.; Sarkhel, S.; and Park, C. 2026. Rethinking Failure Attribution in Multi-Agent Systems: A Multi-Perspective Benchmark and Evaluation. arXiv:2603.25001.
- Laminar. 2025. Signals: Structured Event Extraction from Traces. <https://docs.lmn.ai/signals/introduction>.
- LangChain. 2024. LangSmith Observability. <https://docs.langchain.com/langsmith/observability>.
- LangChain. 2026. LangSmith Insights. <https://docs.langchain.com/langsmith/insights>.
- Langfuse. 2024. Langfuse Observability. <https://langfuse.com/docs/observability/overview>.
- Lewis, D. D.; Yang, Y.; Rose, T. G.; and Li, F. 2004. RCV1: A New Benchmark Collection for Text Categorization Research. *Journal of Machine Learning Research*, 5: 361–397.
- Li, H.; Yao, Y.; Zhu, L.; Feng, R.; Ye, H.; Wang, J.; He, Y.; Zou, P.; Zhang, L.; Lei, X.; Huang, H.; Deng, K.; Sun, M.; Zhang, Z.; Ye, H.; and Liu, J. 2026. CodeTracer: Towards Traceable Agent States. arXiv:2604.11641.
- Liu, S.; Chen, Y.; Krishna, R.; Sinha, S.; Ganhotra, J.; and Jabbarvand, R. 2026a. Process-Centric Analysis of Agentic Software Systems. *Proceedings of the ACM on Programming Languages*, 10(OOPSLA1): 1961–1988.

- Liu, Y.; Zhang, C.; Han, Z.; Liu, H.; Wang, Y.; Yu, Y.; Wang, X.; and Yin, Y. 2026b. TrajAD: Trajectory Anomaly Detection for Trustworthy LLM Agents. *arXiv preprint arXiv:2602.06443*.
- Lù, X. H.; Kazemnejad, A.; Meade, N.; Patel, A.; Shin, D.; Zambrano, A.; Stańczak, K.; Shaw, P.; Pal, C. J.; and Reddy, S. 2025. AgentRewardBench: Evaluating Automatic Evaluations of Web Agent Trajectories. *arXiv preprint arXiv:2504.08942*.
- Ma, C.; Zhang, J.; Zhu, Z.; Yang, C.; Yang, Y.; Jin, Y.; Lan, Z.; Kong, L.; and He, J. 2024. AgentBoard: An Analytical Evaluation Board of Multi-turn LLM Agents. In *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems*, volume 37, 74325–74362.
- Mace, J.; Roelke, R.; and Fonseca, R. 2015. Pivot Tracing: Dynamic Causal Monitoring for Distributed Systems. In *Proceedings of the 25th Symposium on Operating Systems Principles*, 378–393.
- MacQueen, J. B. 1967. Some Methods for Classification and Analysis of Multivariate Observations. In *Proceedings of the Fifth Berkeley Symposium on Mathematical Statistics and Probability*, volume 1, 281–297.
- Mazaheri, P.; and Mazaheri, K. 2026. AgentAtlas: Beyond Outcome Leaderboards for LLM Agents. *arXiv preprint arXiv:2605.20530*.
- McCallum, A.; and Nigam, K. 1998. A Comparison of Event Models for Naive Bayes Text Classification. In *AAAI-98 Workshop on Learning for Text Categorization*, 41–48.
- Mulian, H.; Zeltyn, S.; Levy, I.; Galanti, L.; Yaeli, A.; and Shlomov, S. 2026. AgentFixer: From Failure Detection to Fix Recommendations in LLM Agentic Systems. In *Proceedings of the 1st International Workshop on Agentic Engineering (AGENT '26, co-located with ICSE)*.
- Nian, J.; Chen, K.; Zhang, G.; Cao, Y.; and Jiang, Y. 2026. TraceGraph: Shared Decision Landscapes for Diagnosing and Improving Agent Trajectories. *arXiv:2605.31308*.
- OpenAI. 2025. Codex CLI: Lightweight Coding Agent That Runs in Your Terminal. <https://github.com/openai/codex>.
- OpenTelemetry. 2024. OpenTelemetry GenAI Semantic Conventions. <https://github.com/open-telemetry/semantic-conventions-genai>.
- Qwen Team. 2026. Qwen3.6-27B: Flagship-Level Coding in a 27B Dense Model. Official model card.
- Robertson, S. 2008. A New Interpretation of Average Precision. In *Proceedings of the 31st Annual International ACM SIGIR conference on Research and Development in Information Retrieval*, 689–690.
- Rosenberg, A.; and Hirschberg, J. 2007. V-Measure: A Conditional Entropy-Based External Cluster Evaluation Measure. In *Proceedings of the 2007 Joint Conference on Empirical Methods in Natural Language Processing and Computational Natural Language Learning*, 410–420.
- Ruokolainen, T.; Kohonen, O.; Sirts, K.; Grönroos, S.-A.; Kurimo, M.; and Virpioja, S. 2016. A Comparative Study of Minimally Supervised Morphological Segmentation. *Computational Linguistics*, 42(1): 91–120.
- Sajadi, A.; Nguyen, T.; Huynh, K.; Parra, E.; and Chatterjee, P. 2026. TraceView: Interactive Visualization of Agentic Program Repair Trajectories. *arXiv:2606.22110*.
- Shu, R.; Chong, C. Y.; Zhou, X.; Peng, Y.; Wu, Z.; Han, X.; Zhuang, Z.; Yuan, G.; and Wang, Y. 2026. What Resolve Rate Hides: Trajectory Structure Diagnostics for Coding Agents. *arXiv:2607.06184*.
- Wang, J.; Feng, Z.; Wu, J.; Li, R.; Xie, Q.; Ren, Y.; Zhu, H.; Han, X.; Meng, F.; Feng, J.; and Liu, J. 2026a. Where Do Deep-Research Agents Go Wrong? Span-Level Error Localization in Agent Trajectories. *arXiv preprint arXiv:2606.02060*.
- Wang, J.; Hou, J.; Wang, F.; Jian, P.; Bao, C.; and Lv, Z. 2026b. HINTBench: Horizon-Agent Intrinsic Non-Attack Trajectory Benchmark. *arXiv preprint arXiv:2604.13954*.
- Wang, R.; Jansen, P.; Côté, M.-A.; and Ammanabrolu, P. 2022. ScienceWorld: Is Your Agent Smarter than a 5th Grader? In *Proceedings of the 2022 Conference on Empirical Methods in Natural Language Processing*, 11279–11298.
- Wang, X.; Wang, B.; Lu, D.; Yang, J.; Xie, T.; et al. 2025. AgentNet. <https://huggingface.co/datasets/xlangai/AgentNet>.
- Wang, Y.; Wu, W.; Wang, J.; and Wang, Q. 2026c. From Flat Logs to Causal Graphs: Hierarchical Failure Attribution for LLM-based Multi-Agent Systems. *arXiv:2602.23701*.
- WukLab. 2025. OSWorld-Human. <https://github.com/WukLab/osworld-human>.
- xAI. 2026. Introducing Grok 4.5. <https://x.ai/news/grok-4-5>.
- Xie, T.; Zhang, D.; Chen, J.; Li, X.; Zhao, S.; Cao, R.; Hua, T. J.; Cheng, Z.; Shi, D.; Tong, J.; Lu, K.-W.; Garg, V.; Wang, Y.; Dai, Z.; Li, F.; Bisk, Y.; and Yu, T. 2024. OSWorld: Benchmarking Multimodal Agents for Open-Ended Tasks in Real Computer Environments. In *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems 37 (NeurIPS), Datasets and Benchmarks Track*.
- Yang, J.; Jimenez, C. E.; Wettig, A.; Lieret, K.; Yao, S.; Narasimhan, K.; and Press, O. 2024. SWE-agent: Agent-Computer Interfaces Enable Automated Software Engineering. In *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems 37 (NeurIPS)*.
- Zheng, L.; Chiang, W.-L.; Sheng, Y.; Zhuang, S.; Wu, Z.; Zhuang, Y.; Lin, Z.; Li, Z.; Li, D.; Xing, E. P.; Zhang, H.; Gonzalez, J. E.; and Stoica, I. 2023. Judging LLM-as-a-Judge with MT-Bench and Chatbot Arena. In *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems 36 (NeurIPS), Datasets and Benchmarks Track*.
- Zheng, Y.; Hu, Y.; Yu, T.; and Quinn, A. 2025. AgentSight: System-Level Observability for AI Agents Using eBPF. In *Proceedings of the 4th Workshop on Practical Adoption Challenges of ML for Systems (PACML '25, co-located with SOSP)*.
- Zhong, Z.; Saxena, S.; and Raghunathan, A. 2026. Hodoscope: Unsupervised Monitoring for AI Misbehaviors. *arXiv:2604.11072*.